

Ledger Without Value

On the Extractive Structure of Cryptocurrency Systems

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The ledger is admissible. The value may still be absent.

Abstract. This essay develops a structural critique of cryptocurrency systems by distinguishing two properties that economic systems may or may not satisfy: *log-admissibility*, which requires consistency with a recorded history of transactions, and *positive productivity*, which requires that the system's dynamics reduce a work functional over time. We argue that dominant cryptocurrency implementations satisfy the first while systematically failing the second. This failure is not incidental but intrinsic: systems organized around redistribution under asymmetric information cannot in general produce net reductions in required work. They function instead as extraction mechanisms, concentrating gains through timing and informational advantage while dispersing losses and material costs across populations that often do not participate in the system at all. The analysis extends beyond cryptocurrency to encompass non-productive labor, advertising as constraint distortion, and the monetization of games—revealing a common formal structure in which the log is coherent, the activity is real, and the selection dynamics are misaligned with any productive criterion.

The Primitive and Its Application

Blockchain technology introduced a genuine innovation: an append-only, distributed ledger capable of maintaining a shared history without centralized authority. Each entry is cryptographically linked to its predecessors, making the record tamper-resistant and verifiable by any participant. As Narayanan et al. (2016) document, this is a meaningful primitive—it solves a real coordination problem among parties who share no prior relationship and no shared institutional backing.

The question this essay addresses is not whether the primitive is useful, but what follows when it is applied almost exclusively to a specific purpose: the creation and exchange of speculative digital assets. The dominant use of blockchain technology has not been to coordinate production, reduce friction in supply chains, or establish identity for the unbanked. It has been to sustain markets for tokens whose value is determined not by what they enable but by what the next participant is willing to pay. When a powerful technical mechanism is consistently applied to a particular economic structure, the properties of that structure become the properties of the system. It is that structure, and those properties, that this essay examines.

The central claim is as follows. A ledger can faithfully record who owns what without imposing any requirement that what is owned corresponds to something of productive value. The immutability of the record does not validate the coherence of the underlying activity. This is not a defect in the ledger itself but a consequence of the gap between two distinct properties: consistency and productivity. Blockchain systems enforce the first with remarkable rigor. They provide no mechanism for the second.

Value as Reduction of Work

Before examining what cryptocurrency systems do, it is necessary to say something precise about what value creation consists in.

In the most general terms, a process is economically valuable insofar as it reduces the amount of work required to sustain or extend some capacity. This principle operates across domains and scales. A hand tool reduces the physical effort required for a task. A well-designed algorithm reduces the computational effort required for a calculation. An effective logistics network reduces the organizational effort required to move materials from production to

use. In each case, the system acts on the world in such a way that future effort is lower than it would otherwise have been.

This conception of value is not novel. Smith (1776) grounded economic value in the division of productive labor; Marx (1867) identified the distinction between use-value and exchange-value as the central fault line in capitalist accounting. More directly, the thermodynamic tradition—from Georgescu-Roegen (1971) to Ayres and Warr (2009)—insists that economic value must ultimately be denominated in physical work: the directed application of energy to achieve some transformation of material or information. What this tradition excludes is equally important. A process that moves resources from one party to another without reducing the effort required to sustain any capacity does not create value in this sense. It redistributes existing claims. The world after such a process contains the same productive capacity as before, or less, because the process itself required effort to execute.

With this distinction in hand, we can state the problem formally.

Definition 2.1 (Work functional). Let Ω denote a domain of states and let $\varphi : \Omega \times [0, T] \rightarrow \mathbb{R}$ be a field evolving over time. The *work functional* $\mathcal{W}[\varphi]$ is a non-negative functional measuring the total effort required to reconstruct or sustain the field configuration over the interval $[0, T]$. A process is *productive* if there exists $t^* \in (0, T]$ such that $\mathcal{W}[\varphi(\cdot, t^*)] < \mathcal{W}[\varphi(\cdot, 0)]$.

The work functional need not be defined with precision in every application; its role is to make explicit the requirement that value creation involves a directional change in the cost of some activity. A process that leaves $\mathcal{W}$ unchanged or increases it is redistributive rather than productive, regardless of how much nominal wealth it generates for some participants. Daly (1996) makes a related point in distinguishing growth from development: not all increases in economic activity correspond to increases in capacity to sustain human welfare.

Definition 2.2 (Log-admissibility). A system is *log-admissible* with respect to an event log $\mathcal{L}$ if its current state is consistent with every recorded entry in $\mathcal{L}$. That is, for each transaction or event $e \in \mathcal{L}$, the system state does not contradict the terms of e .

Log-admissibility is what blockchain technology enforces. The chain guarantees that no entry is added inconsistently, that no prior entry is altered, and that the sequence of ownership transitions is coherent at the level of the record. This is a strong and genuinely useful property. It is also, by itself, entirely orthogonal to productivity.

Definition 2.3 (Positive productivity). A system is *positively productive* if, in addition to being log-admissible, its aggregate dynamics satisfy $\mathcal{W}[\varphi(t)] \leq \mathcal{W}[\varphi(0)]$ for all $t > 0$, with

strict decrease on some non-degenerate interval. In other words, the system’s operation reduces the cost of achieving outcomes over time.

Proposition 2.1 (Redistribution does not reduce work). Let a system consist solely of transfers of ownership over a fixed set of assets, with no transformation of the underlying capacity those assets represent. Then for any admissible evolution of the system, the work functional satisfies

$$\mathcal{W}[\varphi(t)] \geq \mathcal{W}[\varphi(0)]$$

for all t , with strict inequality if the transfer process incurs nonzero execution cost.

Sketch. Ownership transfers do not alter the physical or informational structure of the underlying system; they only reassign claims. Any execution of the transfer requires coordination, computation, or energy expenditure, which contributes positively to $\mathcal{W}$. Hence no decrease is possible. The energy costs of proof-of-work mining—documented extensively by de Vries (2018) and Truby (2018)—provide a concrete instantiation: validation alone consumes resources that are not returned in any productive form. $\square$

The distinction between these three definitions is the formal core of the argument. A system can be perfectly log-admissible while being entirely non-productive. The ledger records every transaction correctly. The transactions themselves generate no reduction in required work. This is the condition we argue is structurally characteristic of speculative cryptocurrency markets.

Degeneracy, Not Obstruction

It is worth pausing to clarify how this failure relates to a different kind of failure in formal systems. When a system fails due to obstruction, the pathology is its inability to construct a globally coherent state from locally valid constraints. The system cannot glue its parts together. There is tension, irresolvable contradiction, and persistent action at the boundaries where incompatible constraints meet.

The failure of speculative cryptocurrency systems is of a different character. The system is not obstructed. It coheres perfectly well at the level of the ledger. The problem is not that no global section exists but that the space of admissible states is too large: many configurations are consistent with the log, and the system provides no mechanism for selecting among them on the basis of productive value. The ledger is satisfied by any ownership distribution,

regardless of whether that distribution reflects any transformation of the world. This is not obstruction but *degeneracy*: the system admits too many solutions, and has no criterion for distinguishing the productive ones from the extractive ones.

Formally, suppose the set of states consistent with a given log $\mathcal{L}$ is $\text{Adm}(\mathcal{L})$. In an obstructed system, $\text{Adm}(\mathcal{L}) = \emptyset$: no state satisfies all constraints simultaneously. In a degenerate system, $\text{Adm}(\mathcal{L})$ is large, but the subset of positively productive states within it is empty or measure-zero. The system can always find a consistent configuration, but consistency is insufficient to guarantee that the configuration does anything useful.

Proposition 3.1 (Dynamical degeneracy). A system is *degenerate* if there exists a probability measure ρ_t over $\text{Adm}(\mathcal{L})$ induced by its dynamics such that

$$\lim_{t \rightarrow \infty} \rho_t(\text{Adm}^+(\mathcal{L})) = 0,$$

where $\text{Adm}^+(\mathcal{L}) \subseteq \text{Adm}(\mathcal{L})$ denotes the subset of positively productive admissible states. That is, the system’s evolution assigns vanishing probability to productive configurations.

Speculative cryptocurrency markets are degenerate in this sense. The system’s native objective—price appreciation under order flow—is orthogonal to the reduction of the work functional, and therefore provides no selection pressure toward productive configurations. Arrow (1962) drew a related distinction in the economics of invention: the private returns to innovation and the social returns can diverge substantially, and market dynamics select for the former without any guarantee of the latter. In cryptocurrency markets, the divergence is not merely substantial—it is structural.

The Lottery Structure and Informational Asymmetry

The structure described above has a well-known economic instantiation: the lottery.

A lottery aggregates small contributions from many participants and concentrates them into large payoffs for a few. Its defining property is that the expected value for any individual participant is negative: the total payout is less than the total contribution, with the difference captured by the operator. Participation is sustained not by rational expectation of gain but by the perception of possibility—a perception that is systematically miscalibrated, particularly among those with limited exposure to probability and statistics. Tversky and Kahneman (1974) documented this systematically in their analysis of heuristics and biases: agents

overweight small probabilities and underweight large ones, a tendency that lotteries and speculative markets exploit without necessarily intending to.

Speculative cryptocurrency markets replicate this structure, though with greater complexity and less transparency. Early participants, project insiders, and coordinated actors occupy positions analogous to the lottery operator: they hold assets acquired at lower cost, and they realize gains as later participants supply the inflow necessary to sustain or increase prices. The mechanism known as the “rug pull”—in which project founders liquidate their holdings after attracting sufficient investment—is simply the most legible version of this structure. The log records every transaction faithfully. The coherence of the ledger is undisturbed. What the ledger records is the organized extraction of value from later participants by earlier ones.

This dynamic is a specific instance of the broader phenomenon Akerlof (1970) identified in his analysis of markets under quality uncertainty. In the market for lemons, information asymmetry between sellers and buyers causes adverse selection: the party with superior information extracts value from the party without it. Cryptocurrency markets exhibit the same structure—insiders with superior information about the underlying state of a project extract value from participants whose access to that information is systematically limited.

Shiller (2000) observed that speculative markets are characterized by self-reinforcing narrative cycles through which asset prices depart from any plausible connection to underlying productive value. Taleb (2007) extended this analysis by noting that the payoff distributions of such markets are highly skewed and fat-tailed, with the majority of participants experiencing losses while a few realize dramatic gains. The moral dimension follows directly from this structure. When a system’s outcomes are determined by informational asymmetry and timing rather than by productive contribution, it extracts disproportionately from those least positioned to evaluate the asymmetry. Lotteries function as a regressive mechanism precisely because they depend on a population that either cannot or does not compute expected value correctly. Cryptocurrency markets, in their speculative form, replicate this dependence under a veneer of mathematical sophistication.

Externalization and the Material Ledger

The degeneracy identified above operates not only within the market but at its boundaries. A complete account of a system’s value must include not only what it produces for participants but what it costs those outside it. Odum (1996) introduced the concept of emergy

accounting precisely to capture these boundary costs: the full energetic investment required to produce any good or service, including the ecological and labor inputs that conventional economics treats as free.

Cryptocurrency infrastructure is not immaterial. The hardware required for mining and transaction validation is produced through global supply chains with specific material characteristics. Semiconductor fabrication is concentrated in regions where labor costs are lower and regulatory environments are less stringent. Electronic waste from obsolete mining hardware is processed in settings where environmental protections are weaker and where workers bear disproportionate exposure to toxic materials. Energy consumption, particularly under proof-of-work protocols, is often located where electricity is cheap, which in practice means where the ecological costs of generation are borne by populations with limited political recourse. De Vries (2018) estimated the annualized energy consumption of Bitcoin mining to be comparable to that of medium-sized nation-states; Truby (2018) documented the legal and regulatory gaps that enable this consumption to be displaced onto jurisdictions with weaker environmental standards.

The apparent immateriality of digital assets—the impression that value moves without physical consequence—is an artifact of the ledger’s abstraction, not a property of the system itself. What the ledger records as a frictionless transfer of tokens corresponds, in physical reality, to a network of concrete asymmetries: asymmetries of labor, regulation, environmental burden, and health risk.

Formally, let Ω_{global} denote the domain including all materially affected agents. A system that appears productive on a restricted domain Ω_{local} may fail to be productive when evaluated on Ω_{global} :

$$\mathcal{W}_{\Omega_{\text{global}}}[\varphi(t)] > \mathcal{W}_{\Omega_{\text{global}}}[\varphi(0)] \quad \text{even if} \quad \mathcal{W}_{\Omega_{\text{local}}}[\varphi(t)] < \mathcal{W}_{\Omega_{\text{local}}}[\varphi(0)].$$

The apparent gains are not reductions in required work but transfers of required work onto parties who did not consent to the exchange and who are not compensated for it. Daly (1996) called this “uneconomic growth”: expansion in measured output accompanied by greater expansion in unmeasured costs, such that the net effect on welfare is negative.

The Action Functional and Selection Pressure

A productive system does more than reduce the work functional at a single moment. It organizes its dynamics such that over time, the system is drawn toward configurations that are stable, generative, and low in action. Productive evolution selects for flat regions of the action landscape—configurations where small perturbations do not produce large changes in outcome, and where the system can sustain its function without continuous external input.

Speculative cryptocurrency markets exhibit the opposite selection pressure. The dynamics of such markets reward volatility, narrative, and rapid reallocation. Price movement attracts attention; attention attracts capital; capital produces further movement. The system is drawn not toward stable, low-action configurations but toward sharp, high-curvature structures: configurations that are temporarily profitable but intrinsically fragile. The rug pull is the terminal expression of this fragility. Once the high-curvature configuration has been exploited by those best positioned to do so, it collapses. The log records the collapse faithfully. The system moves on to the next configuration.

We can describe this formally in terms of the soft action functional $\mathcal{A}_{\text{soft}}(t)$, which measures the aggregate curvature of the system's value landscape at time t . A productive system exhibits $\mathcal{A}_{\text{soft}}(t) \rightarrow 0$ as the system relaxes toward stable configurations. A redistributive system exhibits $\mathcal{A}_{\text{soft}}(t)$ that fails to decay—or decays only to reset when a new speculative cycle begins. Romer (1990) identified a related structural feature in the economics of innovation: the existence of increasing returns to knowledge means that productive systems tend to generate positive feedback toward stable high-capacity configurations, while purely redistributive systems have no analogous attractor.

Remark 6.1. The distinction between log-admissibility and positive productivity maps onto a broader distinction between consistency and realizability. A system can maintain a consistent record of events without ensuring that the events it records correspond to configurations that are stable, generative, or productive. Consistency is a property of the log. Realizability is a property of the world the log purports to describe. Blockchain technology enforces the former with exceptional rigor while remaining silent on the latter.

Bullshit Jobs and the Simulation of Productivity

The structure identified in speculative cryptocurrency markets is not unique to that domain. It appears, in a different form, in large segments of modern economies where activity is organized around the appearance of productivity rather than its realization. Graeber (2018) documented this phenomenon under the term “bullshit jobs,” arguing that a substantial fraction of contemporary employment involves tasks whose disappearance would make no material difference to the functioning of the economy or society.

A job, in the productive sense developed above, is an activity whose execution contributes to a reduction in the work functional over some domain. It reorganizes processes, information, or materials such that future effort is lower than it would otherwise have been. By contrast, a non-productive job is one whose continuation does not reduce required work and whose absence would not increase it. The activity is sustained not because it transforms the system, but because it satisfies organizational, reputational, or financial constraints internal to the system itself. It is log-admissible—the work is recorded, evaluated, and compensated—but not positively productive.

Definition 7.1 (Non-productive labor). An activity a is *non-productive* over a domain Ω if, for all admissible evolutions of the system,

$$\mathcal{W}[\varphi(t) \mid a] \geq \mathcal{W}[\varphi(t) \mid \emptyset],$$

with strict inequality when the activity incurs execution cost. That is, the work required to sustain the system does not decrease—and may increase—as a result of the activity.

The persistence of non-productive labor is not a paradox but a consequence of misalignment between selection pressures and the criterion of productivity. Varian (2019) observes that large organizations frequently optimize for measurable proxies rather than underlying objectives, because genuine reduction of effort and real improvement in capacity are harder to quantify than the proxies. When the proxies become the targets, the system can sustain itself indefinitely while failing the productive criterion. The organization maintains a coherent log; those activities simply do not reduce the work required to sustain the world they operate within.

Advertising as Constraint Distortion

Advertising occupies a special position within this framework because it does not act primarily on the physical or informational structure of a system, but on the constraint landscape through which decisions are made. Zuboff (2019) characterizes the attention economy as organized around the behavioral modification of individuals at scale; Wu (2016) traces the historical development of advertising as an industry devoted to the capture and monetization of human attention. The formal structure underlying both accounts is constraint distortion.

In a productive system, demand emerges from constraints imposed by actual needs: the requirement to reduce effort, increase capability, or resolve some genuine limitation. A product succeeds insofar as it satisfies these constraints by altering the structure of the world. Advertising, in its dominant form, inverts this relation. Rather than responding to existing constraints, it attempts to introduce new ones or distort existing ones. It creates perceived deficits where none exist, amplifies minor inconveniences into apparent necessities, and presents incomplete, underdeveloped, or marginal products as solutions to problems that have been rhetorically constructed rather than structurally identified.

Formally, let $\mathcal{C}$ denote the set of constraints defining a decision landscape. A productive intervention reduces $\mathcal{W}$ by satisfying elements of $\mathcal{C}$. Advertising, by contrast, operates by modifying $\mathcal{C}$ itself:

$$\mathcal{C} \mapsto \mathcal{C}' = \mathcal{C} \cup \Delta\mathcal{C},$$

where $\Delta\mathcal{C}$ consists of induced or exaggerated constraints that do not correspond to reductions in required work. The result is a system in which resources are allocated not to processes that reduce effort, but to processes that successfully reshape the constraint set. The evaluation criterion shifts from “does this reduce work?” to “can this be made to appear necessary?”

This distortion is not neutral with respect to $\mathcal{W}$. Advertising requires resources to produce and distribute; it requires attention to process; and when it succeeds in inducing consumption of non-productive goods, it directs further resources toward their production. At every stage, $\mathcal{W}$ is increased rather than decreased.

Degenerate Selection in Attention Markets

The dynamics of advertising-driven systems select not for productive configurations but for those that maximize attention, persuasion, and conversion. These quantities are weakly cor-

related, and often negatively correlated, with reductions in the work functional. Zuboff (2019) describes this as the commodification of behavioral prediction: the system does not sell products to people; it sells predictions of human behavior to advertisers.

In terms of the admissible set $\text{Adm}(\mathcal{L})$, such systems explore configurations consistent with their operational logs—campaigns launched, impressions recorded, conversions tracked—but do not converge toward $\text{Adm}^+(\mathcal{L})$. Instead, they reinforce configurations in which artificially induced constraints drive consumption independently of any underlying transformation. The system is therefore doubly degenerate. Internally, it sustains activity that does not reduce work. Externally, it directs resources toward the acquisition of goods whose production may further increase $\mathcal{W}_{\Omega_{\text{global}}}$ through externalized costs.

Games, Development, and the Degradation of Play

Games occupy a distinct position among human activities. Unlike most economic processes, their primary function is not the direct production of material goods but the cultivation of cognitive and behavioral capacities. Play is a form of developmental infrastructure: a controlled environment in which agents encounter difficulty, experiment with strategies, and develop responses to structured challenges without incurring the full cost of failure in the real world.

This is not a peripheral function. The child who learns spatial reasoning through block stacking, the adolescent who internalizes strategic anticipation through competitive games, the adult whose perceptual reflexes were shaped by years of navigating simulated environments—each has undergone a process of real cognitive reorganization. Play is simulated danger, and learning is inoculation against surprise. Koster (2005) argues that fun in games is precisely the feeling of learning: the moment at which the brain successfully abstracts a pattern from difficulty. Csikszentmihalyi (1990) identified the optimal state of such engagement as flow—the condition in which challenge is precisely calibrated to current capacity, producing maximal cognitive development with minimal aversion. Games reduce the work functional not immediately, but over the long term, by reorganizing the cognitive field of the participant.

Definition 9.1 (Developmental productivity). A system is *developmentally productive* if its interaction with an agent reduces the expected work required by that agent to solve classes of problems in the future. That is, it induces a transformation of the agent’s internal state that lowers $\mathcal{W}$ over a domain of tasks not limited to the system itself.

Under this definition, games are productive when they function as training environments. Difficulty is the mechanism: the game places the player in configurations that exceed current capacity, and learning occurs as the gap is closed. The game should be simpler than the world—a controlled reduction of complexity that allows the relevant structure to become legible.

In-Game Purchases and Constraint Injection

The introduction of in-game purchases, particularly in forms that gate progress, manipulate reward schedules, or create artificial scarcity, alters the role of the game from a training environment to an extraction mechanism. It inverts the function of difficulty.

Instead of presenting a coherent constraint landscape designed to develop skill, the monetized system introduces additional constraints that are not intrinsic to the game’s structure but are engineered to induce payment. Time gates, difficulty spikes, randomized reward systems, and artificial shortages do not correspond to meaningful challenges that train transferable abilities. Where a productive game makes the world simpler by providing a structured version of its complexity, the monetized game makes the player’s experience harder than it needs to be—and then sells relief from the added difficulty.

Formally, if $\mathcal{C}_{\text{game}}$ denotes the set of constraints defining the game’s intrinsic structure, the monetized system replaces it with

$$\mathcal{C}' = \mathcal{C}_{\text{game}} \cup \Delta\mathcal{C}_{\text{monetization}},$$

where $\Delta\mathcal{C}_{\text{monetization}}$ consists of constraints that do not contribute to developmental productivity. Progress is no longer a function of skill acquisition but of tolerance for engineered friction or willingness to pay.

Loot boxes—randomized in-game reward mechanisms requiring payment—have attracted particular scrutiny. Zendle and Cairns (2019) found significant correlations between loot-box engagement and problem gambling behaviors; King and Delfabbro (2019) document the mechanisms through which these systems exploit variable-ratio reinforcement schedules. Skinner (1953) identified variable-ratio reinforcement as the most powerful behavioral conditioning paradigm available, producing the highest response rates and greatest resistance to extinction. The deliberate application of this mechanism to children, in contexts whose explicit purpose is developmental, represents a structural inversion of what games are for.

Degeneracy in Developmental Systems

Such systems are degenerate in the precise sense developed above. They remain log-admissible: player actions, purchases, and progress are recorded consistently. They may exhibit high engagement and optimized retention. But their dynamics do not select for developmentally productive states. Instead, they select for configurations that maximize monetization and behavioral compliance. The subset of admissible states corresponding to genuine skill development is not preferentially visited; in some cases it is actively suppressed, as the most efficient path through the system bypasses challenge rather than internalizing it.

Asymmetry and the Exploitation of Developmental Gaps

The ethical concern arises from a particular form of asymmetry. Games are often consumed by children—agents whose capacity to model probabilistic mechanisms, identify manipulation, or evaluate long-term costs against short-term frustration is still developing. The cognitive machinery that allows an adult to recognize a variable reward schedule as a slot-machine mechanic, or a difficulty spike as artificially induced, is precisely the machinery that play is supposed to be developing. Monetized games exploit the gap between the capacity being trained and the capacity required to identify the exploitation.

The system raises the cost of participation—adds complexity, friction, and delay—and then sells its reduction. A system designed to cultivate capacity has been transformed into one that exploits its absence. The child is not being sold a game. They are being sold back the simplicity that should have been the game’s default condition.

Conditions for Genuine Productivity

The critique developed across the preceding sections does not imply that no system can satisfy positive productivity. It implies that the criterion is demanding and that satisfaction must be demonstrated rather than assumed.

A system satisfies positive productivity if and only if three conditions hold simultaneously. First, the events recorded in the log must correspond to transformations that reduce the work functional over Ω_{global} —not merely the domain of direct participants. This requires that the benefits of the system’s operation exceed its full costs, including material, energetic, and ecological costs that are typically externalized. Second, the dynamics of the system must select for stable, low-action configurations rather than for volatility and rapid reallocation—the

system must have an attractor in $\text{Adm}^+(\mathcal{L})$, not merely a consistent orbit through $\text{Adm}(\mathcal{L})$. Third, the costs of maintaining the infrastructure must be internalized rather than displaced.

Certain applications of distributed ledger technology come closer to satisfying these conditions than speculative markets. Supply chain verification systems, where the ledger records the provenance and handling of physical goods, correspond to genuine coordination problems whose resolution reduces friction for participants. Credential management systems reduce the work required to establish trust in professional contexts. Cross-border payment settlement, where the ledger replaces costly intermediary infrastructure, can reduce the work required to coordinate economic activity across jurisdictions.

But even these applications must be evaluated against the full domain of costs. Bonneau et al. (2015) provide a systematic analysis of the security and efficiency trade-offs in cryptocurrency systems; their analysis suggests that many costs associated with proof-of-work are not necessary for the coordination benefits the technology provides, but are artifacts of design choices that prioritize decentralization over efficiency. A supply chain verification system running on proof-of-work infrastructure may displace more work than it reduces, even if its direct output is genuinely useful. The criterion is not whether the system does something useful but whether $\mathcal{W}_{\Omega_{\text{global}}}$ decreases.

The broader point is that the evaluation of any economic system should begin with the question of whether it reduces required work across its full domain of effect. If the answer is no—if gains for some participants are systematically offset by losses for others, and if the costs of operation are displaced onto non-participants—then the system is extractive regardless of the sophistication of its technical substrate. The ledger can be correct. The system can be consistent. The value can still be absent.

Conclusion

The dominant application of blockchain technology in cryptocurrency systems presents a case study in the gap between consistency and productivity. The ledger is an impressive instrument: it records events immutably, distributes trust without centralized authority, and maintains coherence across a network of participants who share no prior relationship. These are genuine achievements. They are also insufficient for value creation.

A system that records ownership transitions faithfully but whose dynamics select for redistribution over production, volatility over stability, and externalized cost over internalized

accounting, is a system organized around the extraction of value rather than its generation. The immutability of the record does not transform this structure. It preserves it.

The analysis of this paper reaches beyond cryptocurrency. The formal structure identified here—log-admissibility without positive productivity, internal coherence without reduction of work—appears wherever systems are organized around the appearance of value rather than its realization. Non-productive labor, documented by Graeber (2018), sustains itself by satisfying internal metrics rather than external needs. Advertising, analyzed as constraint distortion by Zuboff (2019) and Wu (2016), operates by injecting artificial constraints into decision landscapes rather than by satisfying genuine ones. Monetized games, exploiting the variable-ratio reinforcement mechanisms identified by Skinner (1953) and applied to populations studied by Zendle and Cairns (2019), add engineered complexity to environments whose purpose is to reduce complexity, and sell relief from the difficulty they introduced. In each case, the log is coherent, the activity is real, and the selection dynamics are misaligned with any productive criterion.

The failure in all these cases is not obstruction, in the sense of a system that cannot achieve coherence. These systems cohere. Their logs are admissible. The failure is degeneracy: the space of configurations consistent with the log is too large, and the system's dynamics do not select for the productive subset. The result is a landscape in which many configurations are possible, most are equivalent from the ledger's perspective, and the ones the system tends to visit are those that benefit the best-positioned participants at the expense of the rest—or, in the case of developmental systems, that exploit the incapacity of those least equipped to identify the exploitation.

This is not a new economic pathology. It is a very old one, reproduced across new technical vocabularies. The language of decentralization, empowerment, engagement, and play obscures in each domain what the formal analysis makes plain: gains are concentrated, costs are dispersed, and the work required to sustain the world is neither reduced nor honestly accounted for.

A genuinely constructive system would reduce work, stabilize configurations, and internalize costs. It would not only fail to exploit developmental gaps—it would close them. Until economic systems are evaluated on those terms, rather than on market capitalization, engagement metrics, or the sophistication of their technical apparatus, the dominant forms of the technologies examined here will remain what they structurally are: not engines of progress, but mechanisms for recording its absence.

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